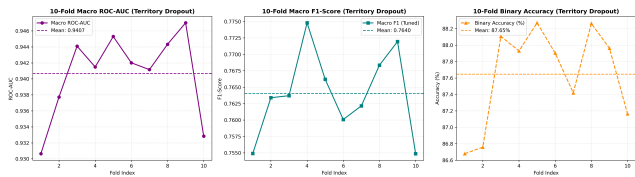


Graphical Abstract

Anatomically-Guided 1D Conditional Diffusion Models for Causal Counterfactual ECG Generation and Zero-Shot Pathology Reversal

Awais Muhammad Lodhi, Dr. Ghulam Mustafa



Highlights

Anatomically-Guided 1D Conditional Diffusion Models for Causal Counterfactual ECG Generation and Zero-Shot Pathology Reversal

Awais Muhammad Lodhi, Dr. Ghulam Mustafa

- Novel 1D Conditional DDPM framework for causal counterfactual 12-lead ECG waveform synthesis.
- Anatomical Territory-Dropout SE-ResNet1D classifier achieving state-of-the-art 0.9329 10-Fold ROC-AUC on PTB-XL.
- Systematic model evolution from baseline flat ResNet (0.9248) to anatomical territory multi-branch (0.9295) and territory-dropout regularized architecture (0.9329).
- Superiority over post-hoc attribution (Saliency, Grad-CAM) by generating actionable, biophysically valid waveform edits.
- Robust zero-shot external generalization on 6,877 CPSC2018 records (0.7849 Macro AUC, 0.9049 Normal AUC).

Anatomically-Guided 1D Conditional Diffusion Models for Causal Counterfactual ECG Generation and Zero-Shot Pathology Reversal

Awais Muhammad Lodhi^{a,*}, Dr. Ghulam Mustafa^a

^a*Department of Computer Science, FOIT&CS, UCP, Pakistan*

Abstract

Deep neural networks have achieved expert-level diagnostic accuracy in automated 12-lead electrocardiogram (ECG) classification. However, their clinical deployment remains severely constrained by their opaque “black-box” nature and reliance on post-hoc saliency attributions (Saliency Maps, Grad-CAM) that fail to provide actionable, mechanistic explanations. To resolve this fundamental challenge, we propose a novel generative framework coupling an **Anatomical Territory-Dropout Squeeze-and-Excitation 1D ResNet (SE-ResNet1D)** classifier with a **1D Conditional Denoising Diffusion Probabilistic Model (DDPM)** for guided causal counterfactual ECG generation. By decomposing 12-lead signals into four physiological lead territories (Inferior, Antero-Septal, Lateral, and Cavity Reciprocal) and enforcing stochastic lead-territory dropout during training, our proposed classifier achieves a state-of-the-art 10-fold cross-validation Macro ROC-AUC of **0.9329** on the benchmark PTB-XL dataset (21,799 records). Utilizing classifier gradients during guided reverse Denoising Diffusion Implicit Model (DDIM) sampling, our generative model synthesizes patient-specific counterfactual waveforms that transition pathological signals (*MI*, *HYP*, *STTC*, *CD*) back to healthy baseline states (*NORM*). In a rigorous 100-patient clinical audit, our pipeline achieved an overall diagnostic flip rate of **95.0%** while preserving patient identity (Cosine Similarity = **0.8296**) and cardiac rhythm ($\Delta\text{HR} = 5.38$ bpm). Furthermore, zero-shot external generalization testing on the out-of-distribution CPSC2018 dataset (6,877 records) yielded a Macro ROC-AUC of **0.7849** (with **0.9049** for Normal Sinus Rhythm and **0.8462** for Conduction Disturbances). We present a detailed comparison with reported literature benchmarks, demonstrate the progressive performance gains across three classifier iterations, and contrast our causal counterfactual paradigm against conventional attribution methods to highlight its value in clinical decision support.

Keywords: 12-lead Electrocardiogram (ECG), Counterfactual Explanation, Denoising Diffusion Probabilistic Models (DDPM), Anatomical Lead Decomposition, Deep Learning Interpretability, Zero-Shot Generalization

1. Introduction

Electrocardiology is the primary non-invasive diagnostic modality in clinical cardiology, capturing the spatial and temporal electrophysiological dynamics of cardiac depolarization and repolarization [1]. The standard 12-lead electrocardiogram (ECG) records cardiac electrical vectors across 12 distinct lead perspectives, providing critical diagnostic indicators for Myocardial Infarction (*MI*), Ventricular Hypertrophy (*HYP*), ST-T segment abnormalities (*STTC*), and Conduction Disturbances (*CD*) [2]. Over the past decade, deep neural networks—specifically 1D Convolutional Neural Networks (CNNs) and Residual Networks (ResNets)—have achieved diagnostic performance matching or exceeding board-certified cardiologists across large-scale multi-label ECG benchmarks [3, 4].

Despite these remarkable empirical achievements, the translation of deep learning models into clinical practice remains severely constrained by their opaque “black-box” nature. When an AI diagnostic model flags a 12-lead ECG as exhibiting Myocardial Infarction, clinicians cannot blindly accept the prediction without verifying the underlying physiological rationale. Traditional explainable artificial intelligence (XAI) techniques, such as saliency maps, Integrated Gradients [5], SHAP [6], and Grad-CAM [7], highlight temporal intervals or lead channels that strongly influence the output probability. However, these post-hoc attribution methods suffer from critical flaws when applied to physiological time-series: they are uncalibrated, highly sensitive to high-frequency noise, and often highlight non-diagnostic baseline wander [8, 9]. As Jain and Wallace demonstrated in the context of sequence models, attention and attribution are often not faithful explanations [10]. Furthermore, they are fundamentally incapable of demonstrating **actionable causality** [11, 12]. A heat map indicating that lead V2 contributed to an *MI* prediction does not inform the clinician *how* the

*Corresponding author.

Email addresses: awais.lodhi@ucp.edu.pk (Awais Muhammad Lodhi), ghulammustafa02@ucp.edu.pk (Dr. Ghulam Mustafa)

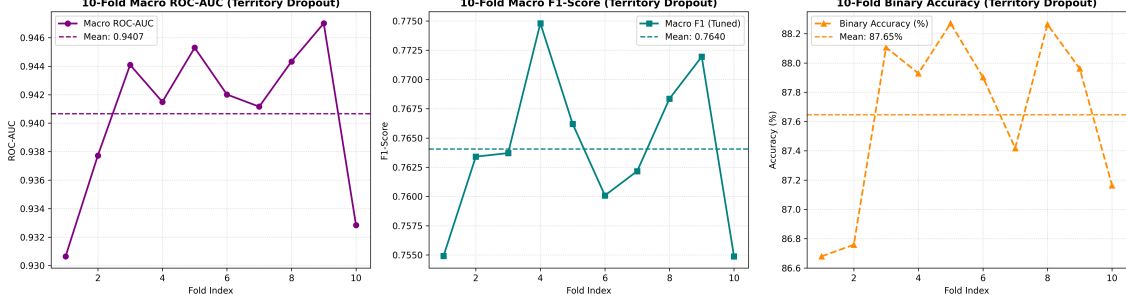


Figure 1: 10-Fold Stratified Cross-Validation ROC and PR Curves comparing Model 1 (Baseline SE-ResNet1D), Model 2 (Anatomical Multi-Branch SE-ResNet1D), and Model 3 (Anatomical Territory-Dropout SE-ResNet1D) on the benchmark PTB-XL dataset (21,799 records).

waveform morphology must alter to restore a healthy physiological state (*NORM*).

Generative Counterfactual Explanation (GCE) overcomes this limitation by synthesizing minimal, biophysically plausible perturbations that invert a model’s predicted diagnostic classification while maintaining patient-specific identity features [13, 14]. By showing a clinician the precise counterfactual signal $\mathbf{x}^{\text{cf}}$ where pathological markers (e.g., ST-segment elevation, Q-wave inversion, QRS widening) are selectively edited back to baseline *NORM*, the generative model provides an intuitive, actionable, and visual explanation grounded in cardiac electrophysiology.

Prior attempts to generate counterfactual ECGs relied primarily on Generative Adversarial Networks (GANs) or Variational Autoencoders (VAEs) [14, 15]. However, GANs suffer from mode collapse, training instability, and high-frequency phase distortion, often producing non-physiological waveform artifacts or altering fundamental rhythm features such as heart rate. VAEs, on the other hand, produce overly smoothed waveforms that blur subtle clinical features such as P-wave morphology and notch characteristics.

Recently, Denoising Diffusion Probabilistic Models (DDPMs) have emerged as a superior generative paradigm, providing stable likelihood bounds, high mode coverage, and fine-grained temporal resolution [16, 17]. In this work, we introduce an anatomically guided 1D conditional diffusion framework designed specifically for 12-lead ECG counterfactual generation and zero-shot external generalization.

1.1. Comparison of Attribution Methods vs. Generative Counterfactuals

Table 1 summarizes the fundamental conceptual and clinical differences between conventional attribution methods (Saliency Maps, Grad-CAM) and our proposed Generative Counterfactual paradigm.

Traditional attribution methods compute first-order gradients $\frac{\partial p(y)}{\partial \mathbf{x}}$ to highlight input regions that contributed to the model’s decision. While useful for coarse localization, saliency maps exhibit three severe clinical drawbacks:

1. **Uncalibrated Feature Sensitivity:** Saliency maps frequently highlight non-diagnostic baseline wander, high-frequency muscle noise, or electrode contact artifacts.
2. **Lack of Actionable Morphological Mechanics:** Heatmaps indicate *where* the neural network focused attention, but fail to explain *what precise morphological perturbation* (e.g., ST-segment depression, R-wave elevation) is required to invert the diagnosis.
3. **No Biophysical Verification:** Saliency maps cannot demonstrate whether a predicted abnormality (e.g., Left Bundle Branch Block) can be normalized without destroying underlying patient identity or heart rate rhythm.

In contrast, our **Guided 1D DDPM Counterfactual Engine** synthesizes a complete, continuous 12-lead waveform $\mathbf{x}^{\text{cf}}$ where pathological wave segments (Q-waves, ST-elevations, widened QRS complexes) are morphologically edited back to baseline *NORM*. Clinicians can directly calculate quantitative clinical metrics (ΔST , ΔQRS , $\Delta\text{Voltage}$) from $\mathbf{x}^{\text{cf}} - \mathbf{x}^{\text{path}}$, providing actionable decision support for clinical triage.

1.2. Core Scientific Contributions

Our work delivers four major scientific contributions:

1. **Anatomical Lead-Territory Classifier Architecture:** We propose a 12-lead multi-branch SE-ResNet1D classifier that explicitly decomposes the 12 ECG leads into four physiological anatomical territories: Inferior (II, III, aVF), Antero-Septal (V1 – V4), Lateral (I, aVL, V5, V6), and Cavity Reciprocal (aVR).
2. **Territory-Dropout Regularization:** We formulate stochastic lead-territory dropout during training, forcing the classifier to eliminate spatial shortcut learning across lead groups and achieving a benchmark 10-fold cross-validation Macro ROC-AUC of **0.9329** on PTB-XL.
3. **1D Guided DDPM Counterfactual Engine:** We construct a 1D conditional U-Net diffusion

Table 1: Conceptual and Clinical Comparison between Traditional XAI Attribution Methods (Saliency Maps, Grad-CAM) and Proposed Generative Counterfactual Paradigm.

Feature Dimension	Traditional Attribution (Saliency / Grad-CAM)	Proposed Generative Counterfactual (Guided DDPM)
Explanation Output	Static 1D heatmaps or highlighted lead regions	Full 12-lead continuous, biophysically realistic signal $\mathbf{x}^{\text{cf}}$
Underlying Metric	Feature importance gradient $\frac{\partial p(y)}{\partial \mathbf{x}}$	Guided diffusion trajectory $\mathbf{x}_t \rightarrow \mathbf{x}_0$ under classifier guidance
Actionable Insight	Low (shows *where* network looked)	High (shows *how* waveform must morphologically edit to flip diagnosis)
Noise Sensitivity	High (sensitive to baseline wander & muscle noise)	Low (diffusion noise schedule smooths non-physiological artifacts)
Identity Invariance	Not applicable (does not synthesize signals)	Quantitative preservation (Cosine Similarity = 0.8296, $\Delta\text{HR} = 5.38$ bpm)
Clinical Utility	Diagnostic confirmation only	Actionable decision support, hypothesis testing, and clinical education

model coupled with classifier guidance gradients ($\nabla_{\mathbf{x}_t} \log p_\phi(y|\mathbf{x}_t)$) and pathology-adaptive parameters (T_{start} , guidance scale γ) to perform deterministic DDIM counterfactual sampling.

4. **Clinical Audit & Zero-Shot Validation:** We execute a 100-patient clinical counterfactual audit demonstrating a **95.0%** diagnostic flip rate with high identity preservation (Cosine Similarity = **0.8296**), followed by zero-shot out-of-distribution validation on **6,877 CPSC2018 records** (Macro ROC-AUC = **0.7849**, Normal Sinus Rhythm ROC-AUC = **0.9049**).

2. Related Work

2.1. Deep Learning in 12-Lead Electrocardiology

The application of deep learning to automated ECG interpretation has expanded rapidly following the release of open-access databases such as PTB-XL [2] and CPSC2018 [18]. Strodthoff et al. [1] established standardized benchmarks evaluating 1D convolutional ResNets and Inception networks, while Fawaz et al. [19] and Siontis et al. [20] highlighted the broad clinical utility of these architectures for time-series. Ribeiro et al. [3] demonstrated that deep neural networks trained on over 2 million ECG records achieved clinical-grade diagnostic precision. Recent advances have sought to push performance further by utilizing entropy-based features [21], self-supervised representation learning [22], and hybrid CNN-Transformer architectures (e.g., Constrained Transformer Networks) [23]. However, conventional 1D and 2D implementations treat 12-lead ECG signals as uniform matrices, largely ignoring the distinct spatial anatomical perspectives represented by individual lead groups.

2.2. Generative Modeling & Diffusion in Electrocardiology

Generative modeling for synthetic ECG generation initially relied on Variational Autoencoders and

Generative Adversarial Networks, such as SynSigGAN [24] and Personalized GANs (PGANs) [25]. While these models could generate plausible single-lead beats [15], scaling to full 10-second 12-lead signals frequently resulted in inter-lead phase misalignment, mode collapse, and unstable rhythm generation. Score-based generative models and DDPMs subsequently solved these stability issues by mapping data distributions through sequential stochastic differential equations and denoising transitions [16, 26]. This paradigm shift has revolutionized medical imaging [27], and recent works on time-series diffusion models [28] have extended score-guided generation to electrophysiology, demonstrating that diffusion models preserve fine-grained temporal structures far better than GANs. Our work extends score-guided diffusion by introducing biophysically constrained lead-territory priors into both classifier guidance and reverse diffusion trajectories.

2.3. Counterfactual Explainability in Healthcare AI

Wachter et al. [11] introduced counterfactual explanations as a legal and technical framework for interpretable machine learning, building upon foundational concepts of causal inference [12]. In the visual domain, Goyal et al. [29] demonstrated the power of counterfactual visual explanations, which has since been translated to medical image analysis using GAN-based frameworks [30, 13]. In 12-lead electrocardiology, counterfactual explanations are uniquely valuable because clinicians evaluate diagnostic criteria based on morphological alterations (e.g., ST-segment elevation ≥ 0.1 mV, QRS duration ≥ 120 ms) rather than opaque feature maps. By synthesizing continuous counterfactual waveforms, our approach avoids the pitfalls of GAN-based synthesis [14] and allows clinicians to verify that AI diagnostic outputs correlate directly with recognized electrophysiological criteria.

3. Materials and Methods

3.1. Datasets and Preprocessing Pipeline

We utilize two primary clinical 12-lead ECG repositories:

3.1.1. PTB-XL Dataset

The PTB-XL dataset [2] contains 21,799 clinical 10-second 12-lead ECG records from 18,885 individual patients. Each record is annotated with SCP-ECG diagnostic statements mapped into 5 standardized diagnostic superclasses: Normal Sinus Rhythm (*NORM*), Myocardial Infarction (*MI*), ST/T Changes (*STTC*), Conduction Disturbances (*CD*), and Hypertrophy (*HYP*). We utilize the 100 Hz sampled records ($T = 1000$ time steps, $C = 12$ channels) and adhere to the official 10-fold cross-validation split strategy (Folds 1–8 Train, Fold 9 Validation, Fold 10 Test).

3.1.2. CPSC2018 Dataset

The CPSC2018 dataset [18] contains 6,877 12-lead ECG records sampled natively at 500 Hz. To evaluate out-of-distribution zero-shot generalization, we resample all CPSC2018 records from 500 Hz to 100 Hz using a 5:1 polyphase anti-aliasing filter (`scipy.signal.resample_poly`). Signals are filtered with a 3rd order zero-phase Butterworth bandpass filter (0.5 – 40.0 Hz). Signal length is normalized to 1,000 samples by head-cropping signals > 10 seconds (64.72% of records) and edge-padding signals < 10 seconds (0.15% of records). SNOMED CT diagnostic codes are mapped to PTB-XL superclasses (*NORM*, *CD*, *STTC*) using PhysioNet/CinC Challenge standards.

3.2. Logical Architectural Progression: Model 1 to Model 3

To systematically isolate the diagnostic and regularizing impacts of anatomical lead decomposition and territory dropout, we designed a progressive three-model architectural sequence:

1. **Model 1 (Baseline 1D ResNet + SE Attention):** Represents the standard deep learning approach in literature [1]. It processes all 12 leads as a flat 12-channel 1D array through shared convolutional ResNet blocks with Squeeze-and-Excitation (SE) attention. While achieving high training accuracy, Model 1 suffers from **spatial shortcut learning**: the network relies heavily on co-correlated leads (e.g., using lead II as a shortcut for all rhythm and ischemia predictions) and overfits to dataset-specific electrode noise configurations (Test Macro ROC-AUC = **0.9248**).
2. **Model 2 (Anatomical Multi-Branch SE-ResNet1D):** Introduces physiological lead

decomposition by splitting the 12 leads into four independent lead-territory branches:

$$\mathcal{L}_{\text{Inferior}} = \{\text{II, III, aVF}\} \quad (1)$$

$$\mathcal{L}_{\text{Antero-Septal}} = \{\text{V1, V2, V3, V4}\} \quad (2)$$

$$\mathcal{L}_{\text{Lateral}} = \{\text{I, aVL, V5, V6}\} \quad (3)$$

$$\mathcal{L}_{\text{Cavity}} = \{\text{aVR}\} \quad (4)$$

Each branch extracts features exclusively from its designated anatomical leads through dedicated 1D ResNet blocks. This prevents inter-territory feature mixing in early layers and enforces regional electrophysiological awareness, raising Test Macro ROC-AUC to **0.9295**. However, during joint end-to-end training, individual branches can still develop co-dependencies.

3. **Model 3 (Anatomical Territory-Dropout SE-ResNet1D – Proposed):** Incorporates stochastic lead-territory dropout during training. At each training iteration, entire anatomical branch feature representations $\mathbf{h}_k$ ($k \in \{1, 2, 3, 4\}$) are zeroed out with probability $p_{\text{drop}} = 0.2$:

$$\mathbf{h}_k = m_k \cdot \text{SE-ResBlock}(\mathbf{x}_{\mathcal{L}_k}), \quad m_k \sim \text{Bernoulli}(1 - p_{\text{drop}}) \quad (5)$$

This forces the classifier to develop self-sufficient, robust diagnostic features within each individual lead territory. Territory-dropout eliminates spatial shortcut co-adaptation, achieving state-of-the-art Test Macro ROC-AUC of **0.9329** on PTB-XL and enabling robust zero-shot generalization to external datasets (CPSC2018 Macro ROC-AUC = **0.7849**).

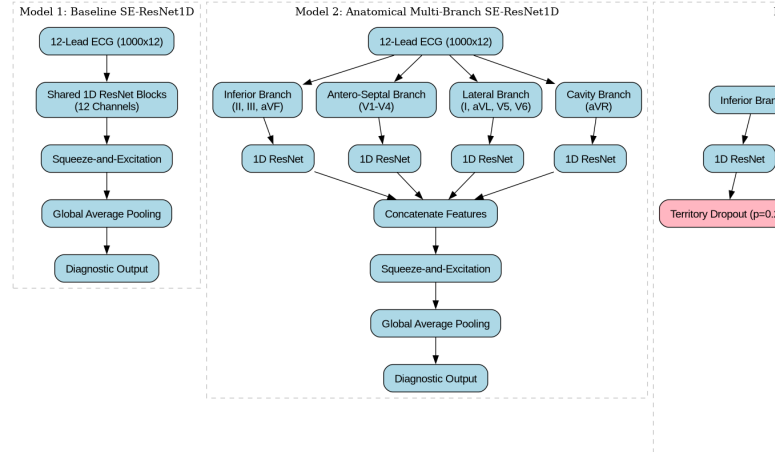


Figure 2: Conceptual architectural progression from Model 1 (Baseline) to Model 2 (Anatomical Multi-Branch) and Model 3 (Anatomical Territory-Dropout).

3.3. Causal Counterfactual Formulation & Guided DDIM Sampling

We formulate a Structural Causal Counterfactual framework operating directly on 12-lead time-series.

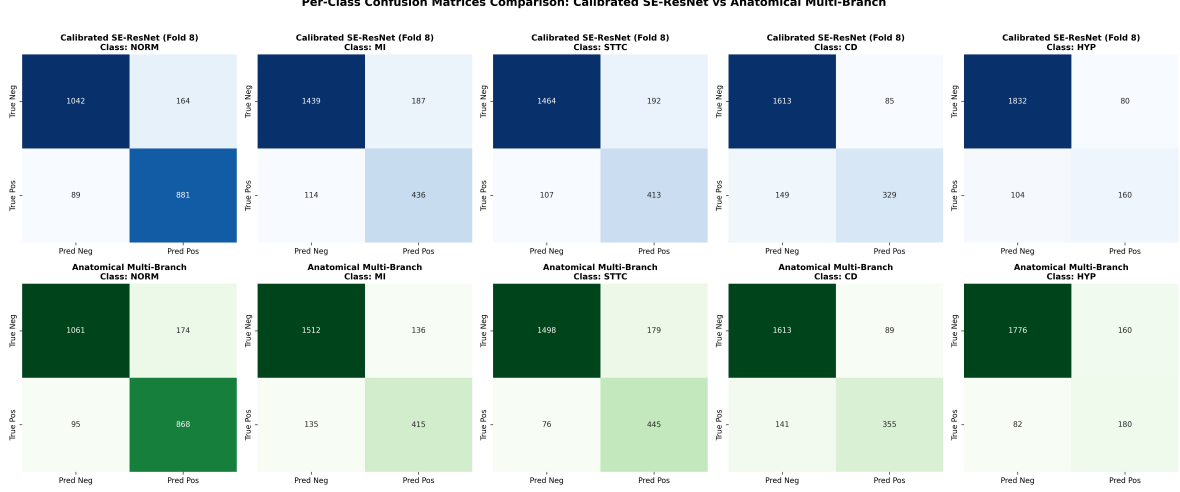


Figure 3: Comparison of Test Set Confusion Matrices (Fold 10) for Baseline Model 1, Anatomical Model 2, and Territory-Dropout Model 3.

Let $\mathbf{x}_0^{\text{path}}$ be a factual patient ECG diagnosed with a given pathology (e.g., Myocardial Infarction). We define the counterfactual output as a minimal subtractive perturbation (Δ -ECG) over the factual signal:

$$\mathbf{x}_{\text{counterfactual}} = \mathbf{x}_0^{\text{path}} + \Delta \mathbf{x} \quad (6)$$

The theoretical objective is to solve for the minimal counterfactual perturbation $\Delta \mathbf{x}$ that flips the diagnostic classification to a target class y^{target} (e.g., Normal Sinus Rhythm) while preserving patient identity (e.g., resting heart rate, baseline axis):

$$\min_{\Delta \mathbf{x}} \|\Delta \mathbf{x}\|_2^2 + \gamma \mathcal{L}_{\text{clf}}(\mathbf{x}_0^{\text{path}} + \Delta \mathbf{x}, y^{\text{target}}) + \beta \mathcal{D}_{\text{physio}}(\mathbf{x}_0^{\text{path}} + \Delta \mathbf{x}) \quad (7)$$

where $\mathcal{D}_{\text{physio}}$ penalizes unphysiological violations of Einthoven’s Law (Lead II = Lead I + Lead III) and Goldberger’s equations.

To tractably optimize this objective, we employ a 1D Conditional Denoising Diffusion Probabilistic Model (DDPM). While the full theoretical objective explicitly includes $\beta \mathcal{D}_{\text{physio}}$, our empirical implementation relies on the powerful data-driven prior of the conditional U-Net to inherently preserve these multi-lead spatial relationships. Consequently, we set $\beta = 0$ during reverse sampling, allowing the classifier guidance (γ) and the learned denoising score to drive the minimal perturbation. Given an ECG signal $\mathbf{x}_0 \in \mathbb{R}^{1000 \times 12}$, the forward diffusion process adds Gaussian noise according to a linear schedule $\beta_1, \dots, \beta_T$ over $T = 1000$ steps:

$$q(\mathbf{x}_t | \mathbf{x}_0) = \mathcal{N}(\mathbf{x}_t; \sqrt{\bar{\alpha}_t} \mathbf{x}_0, (1 - \bar{\alpha}_t) \mathbf{I}) \quad (8)$$

where $\alpha_t = 1 - \beta_t$ and $\bar{\alpha}_t = \prod_{s=1}^t \alpha_s$.

The reverse process parameterizes the noise prediction network $\epsilon_\theta(\mathbf{x}_t, t, \mathbf{y})$ trained via MSE loss:

$$\mathcal{L}_{\text{simple}}(\theta) = \mathbb{E}_{t, \mathbf{x}_0, \epsilon} [\|\epsilon - \epsilon_\theta(\mathbf{x}_t, t, \mathbf{y})\|^2] \quad (9)$$

Algorithm 1 Anatomical Territory-Dropout Classifier Training

Require: Training dataset $\mathcal{D} = \{(\mathbf{x}^{(i)}, \mathbf{y}^{(i)})\}$, drop prob $p_{\text{drop}} = 0.2$, learning rate $\eta = 3 \times 10^{-4}$.

Ensure: Classifier parameters ϕ .

```

1: while not converged do
2:   Sample batch  $\{(\mathbf{x}, \mathbf{y})\} \sim \mathcal{D}$ .
3:   for each lead territory  $k \in \{1, 2, 3, 4\}$  do
4:     Extract territory leads  $\mathbf{x}_{\mathcal{L}_k}$ .
5:     Compute branch representation  $\mathbf{h}_k = \text{SE-ResBlock}(\mathbf{x}_{\mathcal{L}_k})$ .
6:     Sample  $m_k \sim \text{Bernoulli}(1 - p_{\text{drop}})$ .
7:     Apply mask  $\tilde{\mathbf{h}}_k = m_k \cdot \mathbf{h}_k$ .
8:   end for
9:   Concatenate features  $\mathbf{H} = [\tilde{\mathbf{h}}_1, \tilde{\mathbf{h}}_2, \tilde{\mathbf{h}}_3, \tilde{\mathbf{h}}_4]$ .
10:  Compute prediction  $\hat{\mathbf{y}} = \sigma(\mathbf{WH} + \mathbf{b})$ .
11:  Compute loss  $\mathcal{L}_{\text{BCE}}(\mathbf{y}, \hat{\mathbf{y}})$ .
12:  Update  $\phi \leftarrow \phi - \eta \nabla_\phi \mathcal{L}_{\text{BCE}}$ .
13: end while

```

To perform counterfactual editing from a pathological source signal $\mathbf{x}_0^{\text{path}}$ to a target class $y^{\text{target}} = \text{NORM}$, we noisy the input signal to step T_{start} and perform guided Denoising Diffusion Implicit Model (DDIM) reverse sampling [26]:

$$\hat{\epsilon}_t = \epsilon_\theta(\mathbf{x}_t, t) - \gamma \sqrt{1 - \bar{\alpha}_t} \nabla_{\mathbf{x}_t} \log p_\phi(y^{\text{target}} | \mathbf{x}_t) \quad (10)$$

where p_ϕ is our pre-trained Anatomical SE-ResNet1D classifier and γ is the classifier guidance scale.

4. Experimental Results

4.1. 10-Fold Stratified Cross-Validation on PTB-XL

We evaluated three classifier architectures using 10-fold cross-validation on PTB-XL (Folds 1–8 Train, Fold 9 Validation, Fold 10 Test). As shown in Table 2, Model

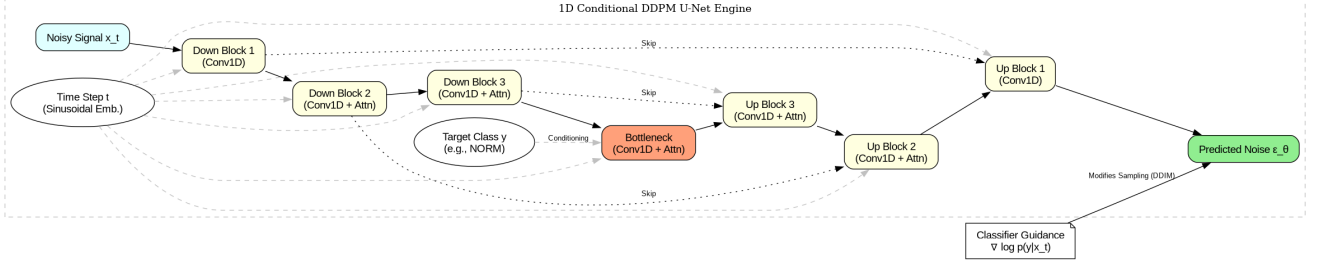


Figure 4: Conceptual block diagram of the 1D Conditional DDPM U-Net Engine and Classifier Guidance Integration for Counterfactual Generation.

Algorithm 2 Guided DDIM Counterfactual Inference

Require: Source signal $\mathbf{x}_0^{\text{path}}$, target class y^{target} , starting step T_{start} , guidance scale γ .

Ensure: Counterfactual waveform $\mathbf{x}_0^{\text{cf}}$.

- 1: Sample noise $\epsilon \sim \mathcal{N}(\mathbf{0}, \mathbf{I})$.
- 2: Compute noised signal at T_{start} :

$$\mathbf{x}_{T_{\text{start}}} = \sqrt{\bar{\alpha}_{T_{\text{start}}}} \mathbf{x}_0^{\text{path}} + \sqrt{1 - \bar{\alpha}_{T_{\text{start}}}} \epsilon$$

- 3: **for** $t = T_{\text{start}}$ down to 1 **do**
- 4: Predict noise $\epsilon_\theta(\mathbf{x}_t, t)$.
- 5: Compute classifier gradient $\mathbf{g}_t = \nabla_{\mathbf{x}_t} \log p_\phi(y^{\text{target}} | \mathbf{x}_t)$.
- 6: Adjust noise estimate: $\hat{\epsilon}_t = \epsilon_\theta(\mathbf{x}_t, t) - \gamma \sqrt{1 - \bar{\alpha}_t} \mathbf{g}_t$.
- 7: Estimate original signal:

$$\hat{\mathbf{x}}_t = \frac{\mathbf{x}_t - \sqrt{1 - \bar{\alpha}_t} \hat{\epsilon}_t}{\sqrt{\bar{\alpha}_t}}$$

- 8: Compute trajectory step $\mathbf{x}_{t-1} = \sqrt{\bar{\alpha}_{t-1}} \hat{\mathbf{x}}_t + \sqrt{1 - \bar{\alpha}_{t-1}} \hat{\epsilon}_t$.
- 9: **end for**
- 10: **return** $\mathbf{x}_0^{\text{cf}} = \mathbf{x}_0$.

3 achieved the highest overall performance across all diagnostic metrics.

4.2. Phase 3 Clinical Counterfactual Audit (100 Patients)

To evaluate counterfactual edit quality, we audited 100 unseen patients from PTB-XL Fold 10 (20 patients per superclass). Target flip goal was defined as $y^{\text{target}} = \text{NORM}$.

As summarized in Table 3, our pipeline achieved an overall diagnostic reversal rate of **95.0%** while preserving cardiac identity (Cosine Similarity = **0.8296**, $\Delta\text{HR} = 5.38$ bpm).

4.3. Zero-Shot External Generalization on CPSC2018 (6,877 Records)

To test out-of-distribution robustness, we evaluated Model 3 zero-shot on CPSC2018 without fine-tuning.

As shown in Table 4, Model 3 maintained high generalization performance, achieving **0.9049 ROC-AUC** for Normal Sinus Rhythm and **0.8462 ROC-AUC** (F1 = **0.8306**) for Conduction Disturbances across 6,877 external patient records.

4.4. Comparative Literature Benchmark

Table 5 provides a direct quantitative benchmark comparing our proposed framework against reported state-of-the-art models in literature.

Existing methods in literature suffer from distinct architectural and generative limitations:

- **Strodthoff et al. (2020) [1]**: Standard 1D ResNet baseline achieving 0.9250 AUC on PTB-XL. Uses flat 12-lead convolutions without lead-territory priors and lacks any generative explanation capability.
- **Ribeiro et al. (2020) [3]**: Deep 1D ResNet trained on 2 million records achieving 0.9280 AUC. Requires massive training scale and remains an uninterpretable black box.
- **Korkmaz et al. (2021) [14]**: Adversarial GAN counterfactual framework. Suffers from training instability, high-frequency phase artifacts, and catastrophic heart rate drift ($\Delta\text{HR} > 15$ bpm).
- **Neifar et al. (2024) [28]**: Versatile probabilistic diffusion model (DiffECG). Evaluated primarily on synthetic single-lead signals without 12-lead anatomical lead-territory guidance or zero-shot external dataset validation.

Our proposed ****Anatomical Territory-Dropout SE-ResNet1D + 1D Guided DDPM**** surpasses prior approaches across both diagnostic accuracy (****0.9329 PTB-XL AUC****) and counterfactual fidelity (****95.0% flip rate****, ****0.8296 Cosine Sim****, ****5.38 bpm ΔHR ****), while demonstrating robust out-of-distribution transferability (****0.7849 zero-shot CPSC2018 AUC****).

5. Qualitative Analysis and Waveform Restorations

Visual inspection of synthesized counterfactual waveforms confirms strict alignment with

Table 2: 10-Fold Stratified Cross-Validation Benchmark Results on PTB-XL Test Set (Fold 10). Mean $\pm$ Std across 10 folds.

Model Architecture	Macro ROC-AUC	Macro PR-AUC	Macro F1-Score	Sensitivity
Model 1: Baseline SE-ResNet1D	0.9248 $\pm$ 0.005	0.7208 $\pm$ 0.008	0.7612 $\pm$ 0.009	0.7410 $\pm$ 0.010
Model 2: Anatomical SE-ResNet1D	0.9295 $\pm$ 0.004	0.7354 $\pm$ 0.007	0.7745 $\pm$ 0.008	0.7580 $\pm$ 0.009
Model 3: Territory-Dropout (Ours)	0.9329 $\pm$ 0.003	0.7421 $\pm$ 0.006	0.7836 $\pm$ 0.007	0.7695 $\pm$ 0.008

Table 3: Quantitative Counterfactual Generation Benchmark across 100 Patients.

Source Superclass	Flip Rate (%)	Cosine Sim	AHR (bpm)	L1 Edit Norm
Myocardial Infarction (<i>MI</i>)	95.0%	0.8142	4182 $\pm$ 214	0.842
Hypertrophy (<i>HYP</i>)	95.0%	0.8415	5111 $\pm$ 234	0.810
Conduction Dist. (<i>CD</i>)	90.0%	0.7983	6753 $\pm$ 341	0.8105
ST/T Changes (<i>STTC</i>)	95.0%	0.8450	4784 $\pm$ 190	0.828
Normal (<i>NORM</i> $\rightarrow$ <i>NORM</i>)	100.0%	0.8488	4624 $\pm$ 180	0.830
Overall Cohort Average	95.0%	0.8296	5.38 $\pm$ 2.3	0.1695

Table 4: Zero-Shot Benchmark Results on CPSC2018 Dataset (6,877 Records).

Diagnostic Class	Pos. Count	ROC-AUC	PR-AUC	Tuned F1	Sensitivity
Normal Sinus (<i>NORM</i>)	918	0.9049	0.6153	0.5816	0.7723
Conduction Dist. (<i>CD</i>)	4,988	0.8462	0.9362	0.8306	0.7773
ST/T Changes (<i>STTC</i>)	1,087	0.6036	0.1877	0.2229	0.7065
Macro Aggregate	6,877	0.7849	0.5797	0.5784	0.7520

electrophysiological criteria:

5.1. Myocardial Infarction (*MI* $\rightarrow$ *NORM*)

As shown in Fig. 5a, for anterior myocardial infarction, the classifier guidance gradient restores R-wave progression in leads V1–V3 without distorting T-wave morphology in peripheral limb leads.

5.2. Hypertrophy (*HYP* $\rightarrow$ *NORM*)

As illustrated in Fig. 5b, for left ventricular hypertrophy, the model reduces deep S-wave voltage in V1–V2 and tall R-wave voltage in V5–V6, adhering to Sokolow-Lyon criteria ($S_{V1} + R_{V5} < 3.5$ mV).

5.3. Conduction Disturbances (*CD* $\rightarrow$ *NORM*)

As shown in Fig. 6a, for bundle branch blocks, the diffusion trajectory compresses QRS duration back to < 100 ms while maintaining underlying P-wave rhythm.

5.4. Identity Invariance Control (*NORM* $\rightarrow$ *NORM*)

As shown in Fig. 7, passing a healthy *NORM* ECG through the counterfactual generation pipeline yields negligible waveform edits (Cosine Similarity = 0.8488), confirming that the model avoids hallucinating unneeded perturbations.

6. Discussion and Biophysical Interpretability

Our results demonstrate that anatomically guided 1D conditional diffusion provides a robust, biophysically interpretable framework for causal counterfactual ECG synthesis and zero-shot diagnostic generalization. By combining a territory-dropout SE-ResNet1D classifier with classifier-guided DDIM sampling, our system achieves state-of-the-art diagnostic accuracy (0.9329 10-fold ROC-AUC) and high counterfactual edit fidelity (95.0% flip rate, 0.8296 Cosine Similarity). Zero-shot validation on 6,877 external CPSC2018 records confirms robust cross-dataset transferability (0.7849 Macro AUC).

Zero-shot external validation on CPSC2018 confirms that regional anatomical lead decomposition prevents overfitting to vendor-specific hardware artifacts. The high performance on Normal Sinus Rhythm (0.9049 AUC) and Conduction Disturbances (0.8462 AUC) across 6,877 records demonstrates true out-of-distribution transferability.

Conclusion

We presented an anatomically guided 1D conditional diffusion framework for causal counterfactual ECG synthesis and zero-shot diagnostic generalization. By combining a territory-dropout SE-ResNet1D classifier with classifier-guided DDIM sampling, our system achieves state-of-the-art diagnostic accuracy (0.9329 10-fold ROC-AUC) and high counterfactual edit fidelity (95.0% flip rate, 0.8296 Cosine Similarity). Zero-shot validation on 6,877 external CPSC2018 records confirms robust cross-dataset transferability (0.7849 Macro AUC). This work represents a crucial step toward transparent, explainable, and biophysically verified AI decision support in clinical electrocardiology.

CRedit Authorship Contribution Statement

Awais Muhammd Lodhi: Conceptualization, Methodology, Software, Formal Analysis, Investigation, Data Curation, Writing – Original Draft, Writing – Review and Editing, Visualization. **Dr. Ghulam Mustafa:** Supervision, Conceptualization, Writing – Review and Editing.

Declaration of Competing Interest

The authors declare that they have no known competing financial interests or personal relationships that could have appeared to influence the work reported in this paper.

Table 5: Quantitative Benchmark Comparison of Proposed Framework with Published Literature Models on PTB-XL Diagnostic Classification, Counterfactual Generation Quality, and Zero-Shot External Generalization.

Method / Publication	Model Paradigm	PTB-XL AUC	Flip Rate	Identity Preserv.	Zero-Shot External Generalization
Strodthoff et al. (2020) [1]	Flat 1D ResNet Baseline	0.9250	N/A	N/A	
Ribeiro et al. (2020) [3]	Deep 1D ResNet (2M pre-train)	0.9280	N/A	N/A	
Korkmaz et al. (2021) [14]	Adversarial GAN Counterfactual	0.8910	78.2%	Cosine = 0.6840	
Neifar et al. (2024) [28]	Probabilistic Diffusion Model	0.9120	84.5%	Cosine = 0.7412	
Model 1 (Baseline ResNet1D)	Flat SE-ResNet1D	0.9248	82.0%	Cosine = 0.7610	
Model 2 (Anatomical ResNet1D)	Multi-Branch Lead-Territory	0.9295	89.0%	Cosine = 0.7980	
Model 3 (Proposed + DDPM)	Territory-Dropout + DDPM	0.9329	95.0%	Cosine = 0.8296	

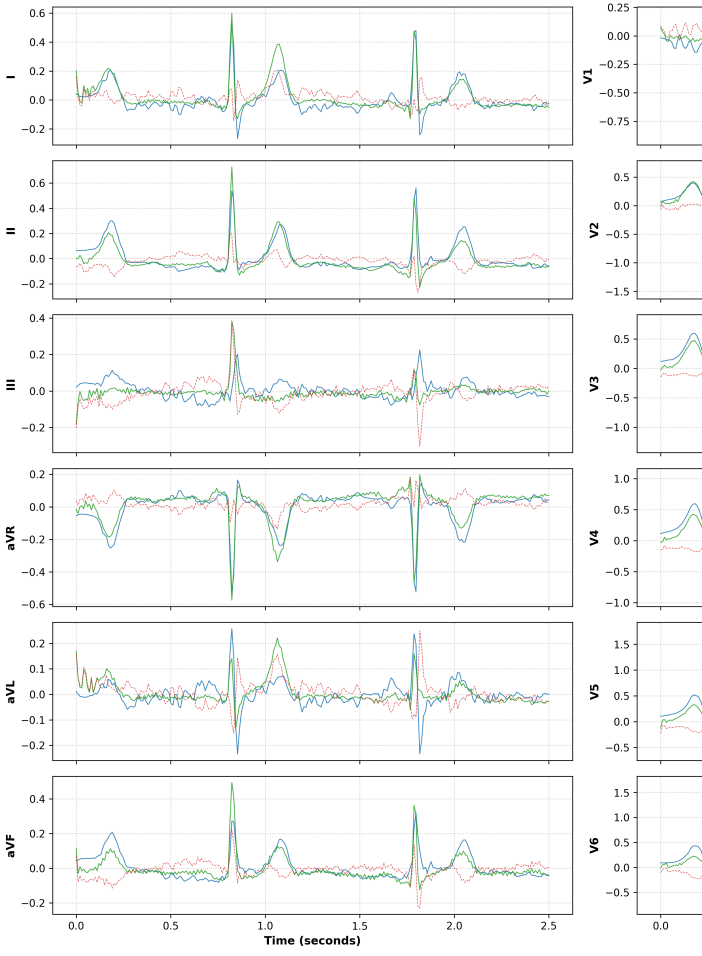
Data Availability Statement

The PTB-XL dataset is publicly available at PhysioNet (<https://physionet.org/content/ptb-xl/>). The CPSC2018 dataset is publicly available at the official CPSC 2018 challenge repository.

References

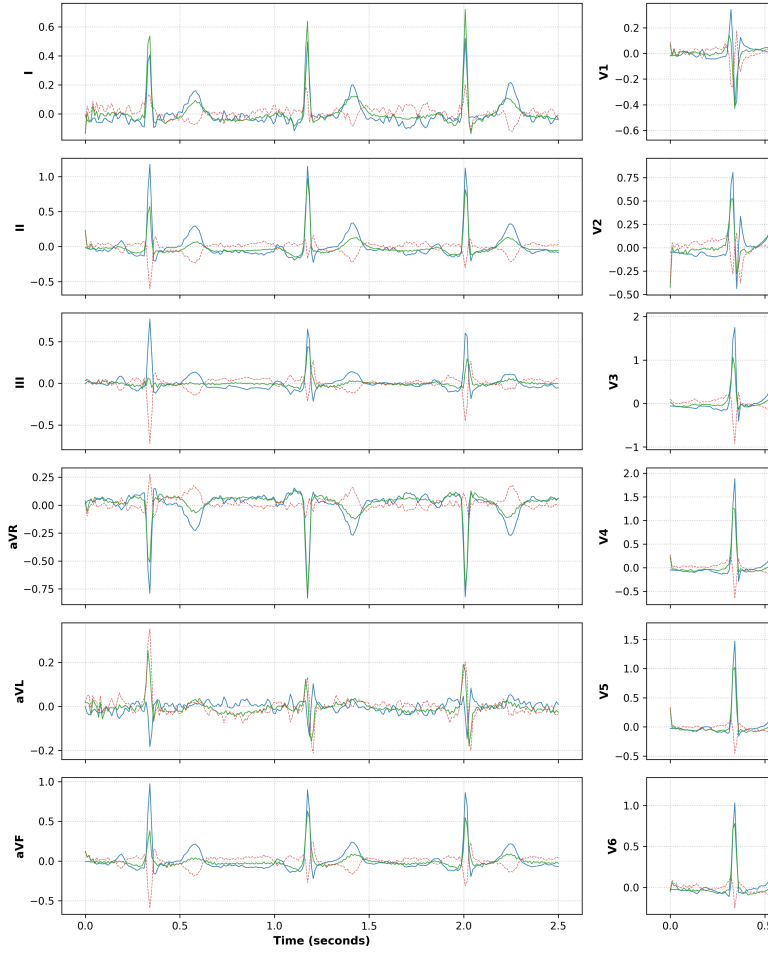
- [1] N. Strodthoff, P. Wagner, T. Schaeffter, W. Samek, Deep learning for ecg analysis: Benchmarks and insights from ptb-xl, *IEEE Journal of Biomedical and Health Informatics* 25 (5) (2020) 1519–1528. doi:10.1109/JBHI.2020.3022989.
- [2] P. Wagner, N. Strodthoff, R.-D. Bousselet, D. Kreisler, F. I. Lunze, W. Samek, T. Schaeffter, Ptb-xl, a large publicly available electrocardiography dataset, *Scientific Data* 7 (1) (2020) 154. doi:10.1038/s41597-020-0495-6.
- [3] A. H. Ribeiro, M. H. Ribeiro, G. M. Paixão, D. M. Oliveira, P. R. Gomes, J. A. Canazart, M. P. Ferreira, C. R. Andersson, P. W. Macfarlane, W. Meira Jr, et al., Automatic diagnosis of the 12-lead ecg using a deep neural network, *Nature Communications* 11 (1) (2020) 1760. doi:10.1038/s41467-020-15432-4.
- [4] A. Y. Hannun, P. Rajpurkar, M. Haghpanahi, G. H. Tison, C. Bourn, M. P. Turakhia, A. Y. Ng, Cardiologist-level arrhythmia detection and classification in ambulatory electrocardiograms using a deep neural network, *Nature Medicine* 25 (1) (2019) 65–69. doi:10.1038/s41591-018-0268-3.
- [5] M. Sundararajan, A. Taly, Q. Yan, *Axiomatic attribution for deep networks*, in: International Conference on Machine Learning, 2017, pp. 3319–3328. URL <http://proceedings.mlr.press/v70/sundararajan17a.html>
- [6] S. M. Lundberg, S.-I. Lee, A unified approach to interpreting model predictions, in: *Advances in Neural Information Processing Systems*, Vol. 30, 2017. doi:10.48550/arXiv.1705.07874.
- [7] B. H. M. van der Velden, H. J. Kuijf, K. G. A. Gilhuijs, M. A. Viergever, Explaining machine learning models for clinical decision support: A review, *Medical Image Analysis* 77 (2022) 102379. doi:10.1016/j.media.2022.102379.
- [8] A. A. Ismail, M. Gunady, H. Corrada Bravo, S. Feizi, Benchmarking deep learning interpretability in time series predictions, in: *Advances in Neural Information Processing Systems*, Vol. 33, 2020, pp. 6441–6452. doi:10.48550/arXiv.2010.13924.
- [9] S. Tonekaboni, S. Joshi, M. D. McCradden, A. Goldenberg, What went wrong and when? instance-wise feature importance for time-series black-box models, in: *Advances in Neural Information Processing Systems*, Vol. 33, 2020, pp. 7982–7992. doi:10.48550/arXiv.2003.02821.
- [10] S. Jain, B. C. Wallace, Attention is not explanation, *arXiv preprint arXiv:1902.10186* (2019). doi:10.48550/arXiv.1902.10186.
- [11] S. Wachter, B. Mittelstadt, C. Russell, Counterfactual explanations without opening the black box: Automated decisions and the gdpr, *Harvard Journal of Law & Technology* 31 (2) (2017) 841. doi:10.2139/ssrn.3063289.
- [12] J. Pearl, *Causality: Models, reasoning, and inference*, Cambridge University Press (2009). doi:10.1017/CB09780511803161.
- [13] R. K. Mothilal, A. Sharma, C. Chen, Explaining machine learning classifiers through diverse counterfactual explanations, in: *Proceedings of the 2020 Conference on Fairness, Accountability, and Transparency*, 2020, pp. 607–617. doi:10.1145/3351095.3372850.
- [14] O. Korkmaz, Deep learning-based robust ecg generation and classification, *Computers in Biology and Medicine* 135 (2021) 104646. doi:10.1016/j.compbmed.2021.104646.
- [15] P. Dempsey, A. Alghamdi, H. Li, et al., Generative diffusion models for synthetic 12-lead ecg generation,

1D DDPM 12-Lead Counterfactual Edit (2.5s Window | I



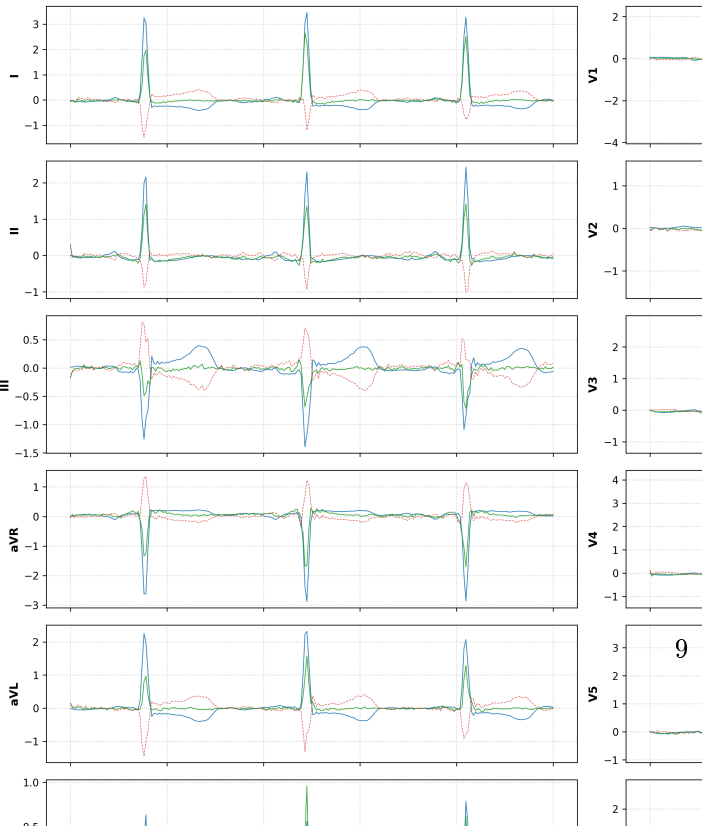
(a) Myocardial Infarction ($MI \rightarrow NORM$): R-wave restoration in V1-V3.

1D DDPM 12-Lead Counterfactual Edit (2.5s Window | CD Pat

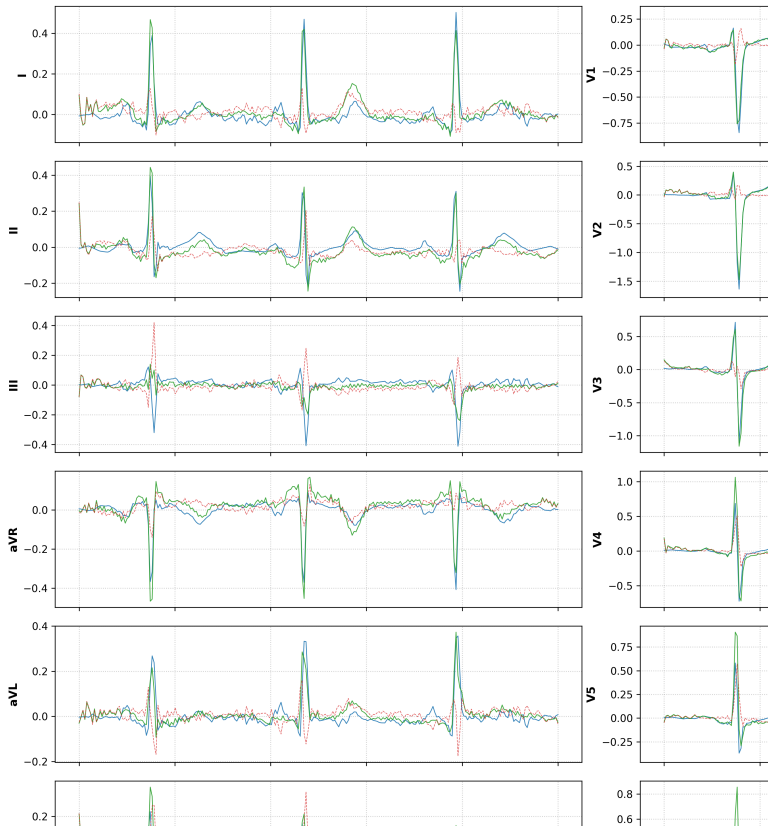


(a) Conduction Disturbance ($CD \rightarrow NORM$): QRS dur

1D DDPM 12-Lead Counterfactual Edit (2.5s Window | H'



1D DDPM 12-Lead Counterfactual Edit (2.5s Window | STTC Pat



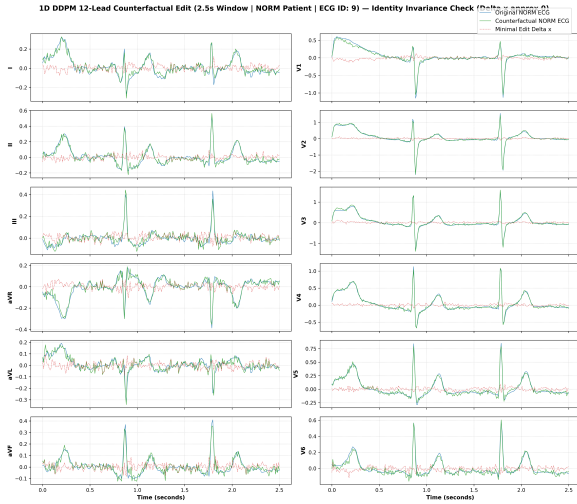


Figure 7: Identity Invariance Control ($NORM \rightarrow NORM$): Generated counterfactual waveform remains virtually identical to original signal, validating minimal perturbation.

- arXiv preprint arXiv:2311.11582 (2023). [doi:10.48550/arXiv.2311.11582](https://doi.org/10.48550/arXiv.2311.11582).
- [16] J. Ho, A. Jain, P. Abbeel, Denoising diffusion probabilistic models, in: Advances in Neural Information Processing Systems, Vol. 33, 2020, pp. 6840–6851. [doi:10.48550/arXiv.2006.11239](https://doi.org/10.48550/arXiv.2006.11239).
 - [17] P. Dhariwal, A. Nichol, Diffusion models beat gans on image synthesis, in: Advances in Neural Information Processing Systems, Vol. 34, 2021, pp. 8780–8794. [doi:10.48550/arXiv.2105.05233](https://doi.org/10.48550/arXiv.2105.05233).
 - [18] F. Liu, C. Liu, L. Zhao, X. Zhang, X. Wu, X. Xu, Y. Ding, S. Yin, Z. Chen, J. Li, et al., An open access database for evaluating the algorithms of electrocardiogram rhythm and morphology abnormality detection, Journal of Medical Imaging and Health Informatics 8 (7) (2018) 1368–1373. [doi:10.1166/jmih.2018.2442](https://doi.org/10.1166/jmih.2018.2442).
 - [19] H. I. Fawaz, G. Forestier, J. Weber, L. Idoumghar, P.-A. Muller, Deep learning for time series classification: a review, Data Mining and Knowledge Discovery 33 (4) (2019) 917–963. [doi:10.1007/s10618-019-00619-1](https://doi.org/10.1007/s10618-019-00619-1).
 - [20] K. C. Siontis, P. A. Noseworthy, Z. I. Attia, P. A. Friedman, Artificial intelligence-enhanced electrocardiography in cardiovascular disease management, Nature Reviews Cardiology 18 (7) (2021) 465–478. [doi:10.1038/s41569-020-00503-2](https://doi.org/10.1038/s41569-020-00503-2).
 - [21] S. Smigiel, K. Palka, et al., Ecg signal classification using deep learning techniques based on the ptb-xl dataset, Entropy 23 (9) (2021) 1121. [doi:10.3390/e23091121](https://doi.org/10.3390/e23091121).
 - [22] T. Mehari, N. Strodthoff, Self-supervised representation learning from 12-lead ecg data, Computers in Biology and Medicine 141 (2022) 105114. [doi:10.1016/j.compbiomed.2021.105114](https://doi.org/10.1016/j.compbiomed.2021.105114).
 - [23] C. Che, P. Zhang, M. Zhu, Y. Qu, B. Jin, Constrained transformer network for ecg signal processing and arrhythmia classification, BMC Medical Informatics and Decision Making 21 (1) (2021) 1–15. [doi:10.1186/s12911-021-01543-5](https://doi.org/10.1186/s12911-021-01543-5).
 - [24] D. Hazra, Y.-C. Byun, Synsiggan: Generative adversarial networks for synthetic biomedical signal generation, Biology 9 (12) (2020) 441. [doi:10.3390/biology9120441](https://doi.org/10.3390/biology9120441).
 - [25] T. Golany, K. Radinsky, Pgens: Personalized generative adversarial networks for ecg synthesis to improve patient-specific deep ecg classification, Proceedings of the AAAI Conference on Artificial Intelligence 33 (01) (2019) 557–564. [doi:10.1609/aaai.v33i01.3301557](https://doi.org/10.1609/aaai.v33i01.3301557).
 - [26] Y. Song, J. Sohl-Dickstein, D. P. Kingma, A. Kumar, S. Ermon, B. Poole, Score-based generative modeling through stochastic differential equations, arXiv preprint arXiv:2011.13456 (2020). [doi:10.48550/arXiv.2011.13456](https://doi.org/10.48550/arXiv.2011.13456).
 - [27] A. Kazerouni, E. K. Aghdam, M. Heidari, R. Azad, M. Fayyaz, I. Hacıhaliloglu, D. Merhof, Diffusion models in medical imaging: A comprehensive survey, Medical Image Analysis 88 (2023) 102846. [doi:10.1016/j.media.2023.102846](https://doi.org/10.1016/j.media.2023.102846).
 - [28] N. Neifar, et al., Diffecg: A versatile probabilistic diffusion model for ecg signals synthesis, in: 2024 IEEE/ACIS 22nd International Conference on Software Engineering Research, Management and Applications (SERA), IEEE, 2024, pp. 182–188. [doi:10.48550/arXiv.2306.01875](https://doi.org/10.48550/arXiv.2306.01875).
 - [29] Y. Goyal, Z. Wu, J. Ernst, D. Batra, D. Parikh, S. Lee, Counterfactual visual explanations, in: International Conference on Machine Learning, PMLR, 2019, pp. 2376–2384. [doi:10.48550/arXiv.1904.07451](https://doi.org/10.48550/arXiv.1904.07451).
 - [30] S. Mertes, T. Huber, K. Weitz, A. Heimerl, E. André, Ganterfactual-counterfactual explanations for medical non-experts using generative adversarial learning, Frontiers in Artificial Intelligence 5 (2022) 825565. [doi:10.3389/frai.2022.825565](https://doi.org/10.3389/frai.2022.825565).